



TCP and Transmission Control

Referred Book: Computer Networks: A Systems Approach, (5th edition), by Peterson and
Davie: 5 End-to-End Protocols; 6 Congestion Control and Resource Allocation

Thanks to some coursework material and slide from Princeton, MIT and Berkley.

1



Outline

- ⊕ The Transport Layer
- ⊕ The UDP Protocol
- ⊕ The TCP Protocol
 - TCP Segments
 - TCP Sequence Numbers
 - TCP Connection setup
 - Timeouts and Retransmission
 - TCP Sliding Window
 - Congestion Control and Avoidance

2



The Transport Layer

What is the transport layer for?

□ Link & network layer, and why transport layer?

□ Many medias, different quality

- Wireless, radio,
- Wired, coaxial cable, twisted-pair cables, Ethernet cable, power cable

What characteristics might it have?

□ Reliable delivery

□ Flow control

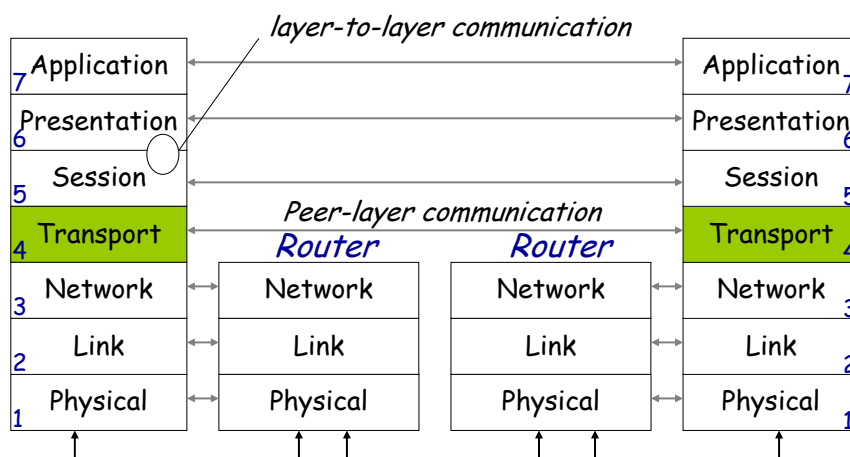
□ Congestion control



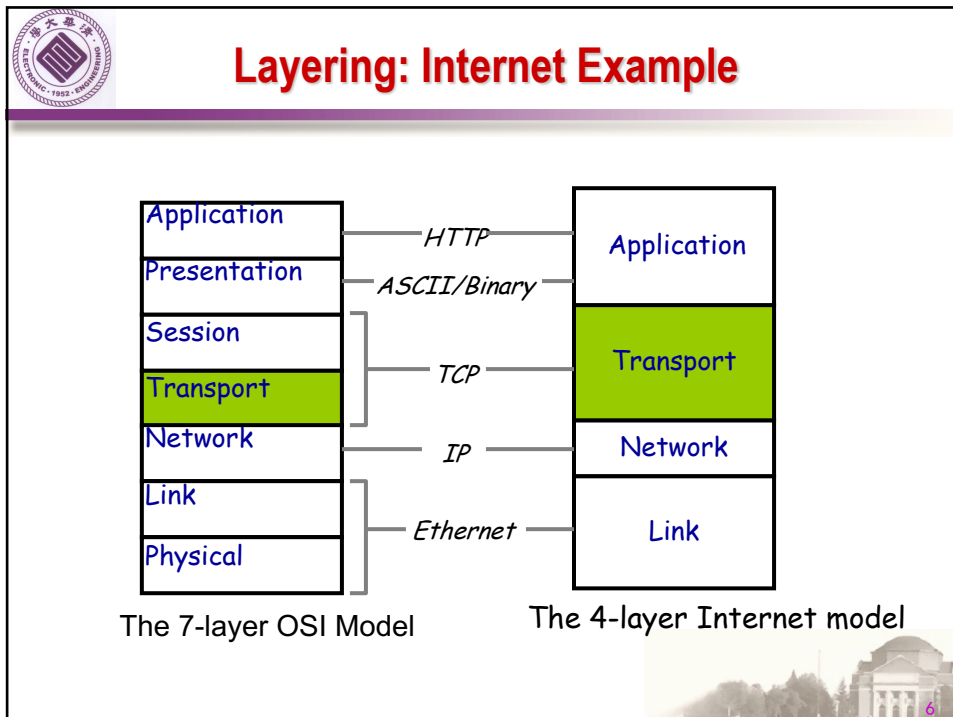
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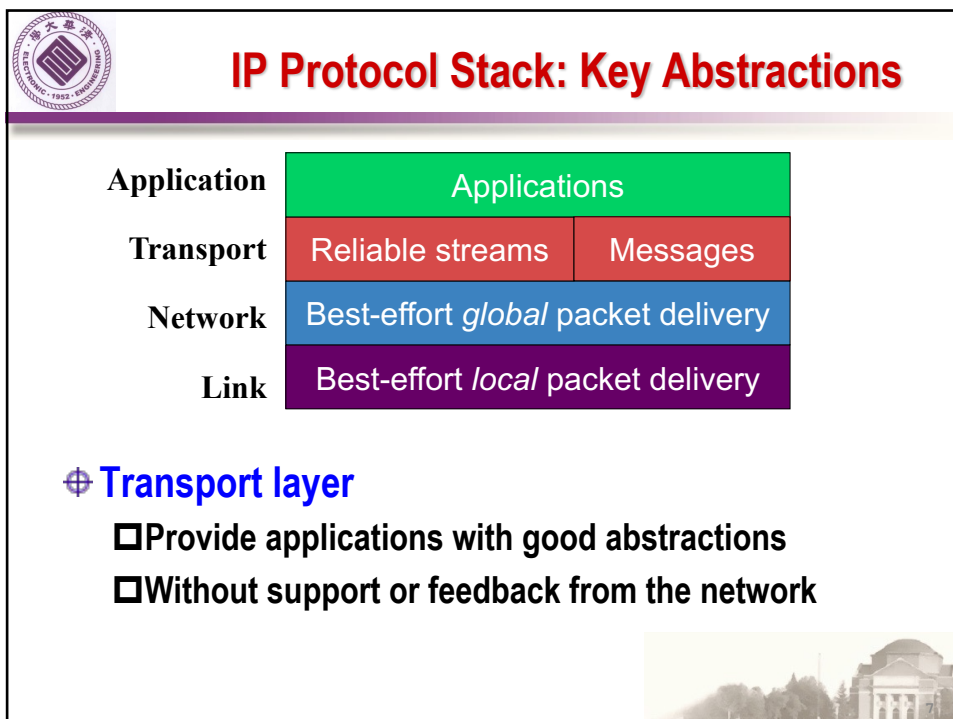
Layering: The OSI Model



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7



Transport Protocols

⊕ Logical communication between processes

- ❑ Sender divides a message into segments
- ❑ Receiver reassembles segments into message

⊕ Transport services

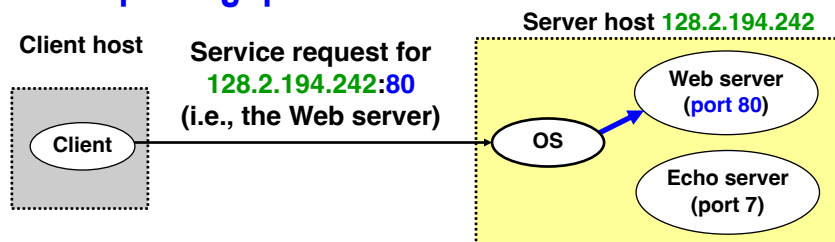
- ❑ (De)multiplexing packets
- ❑ Detecting corrupted data
- ❑ Optionally: reliable delivery, flow control, ...

8

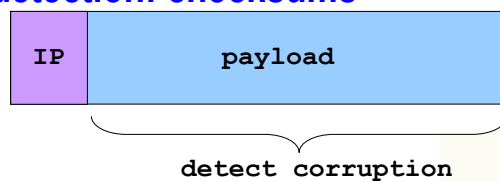


Two Basic Transport Features

⊕ Demultiplexing: port numbers



⊕ Error detection: checksums



9

9



UDP: User Datagram Protocol

⊕ Fine-grain control

❑ UDP sends as soon as the application writes

⊕ No connection set-up delay

❑ UDP sends without establishing a connection

⊕ No connection state

❑ No buffers, parameters, sequence #s, etc.

⊕ Small header overhead

❑ UDP header is only eight-bytes

SRC port	DST port
checksum	length
DATA	

11



Popular Applications That Use UDP

⊕ Multimedia streaming

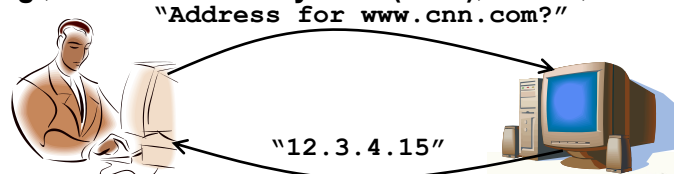
❑ Retransmitting packets is not always worthwhile

❑ E.g., phone calls, video conferencing, gaming, IPTV

⊕ Simple query-response protocols

❑ Overhead of connection establishment is overkill

❑ E.g., Domain Name System (DNS), DHCP, etc.



12

12



TRANSPORT LAYER: FROM UDP TO TCP



13



Transmission Control Protocol (TCP)

⊕ Stream-of-bytes service

- ❑ Sends and receives a stream of bytes

⊕ Connection oriented

- ❑ Explicit set-up and tear-down of TCP connection

⊕ Reliable, in-order delivery

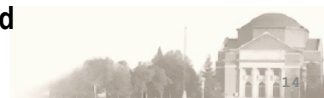
- ❑ Corruption: checksums
- ❑ Detect loss/reordering: sequence numbers
- ❑ Reliable delivery: acknowledgments and retransmissions

⊕ Flow control

- ❑ Prevent overflow of the receiver's buffer space

⊕ Congestion control

- ❑ Adapt to network congestion for the greater good



14



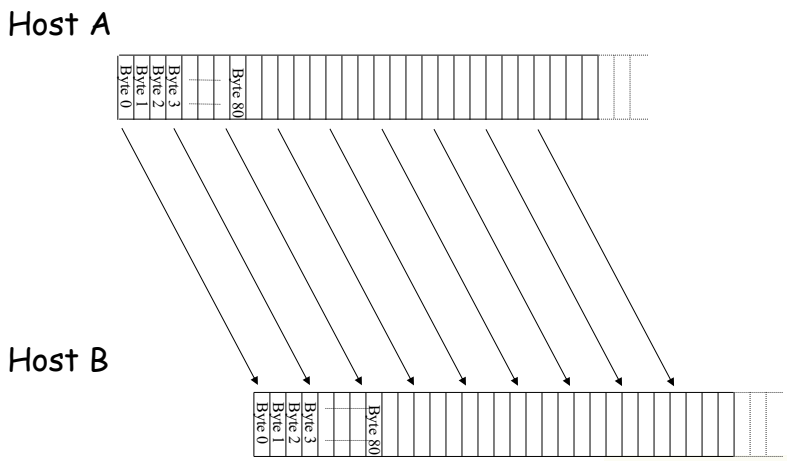
BREAKING A STREAM OF BYTES INTO TCP SEGMENTS



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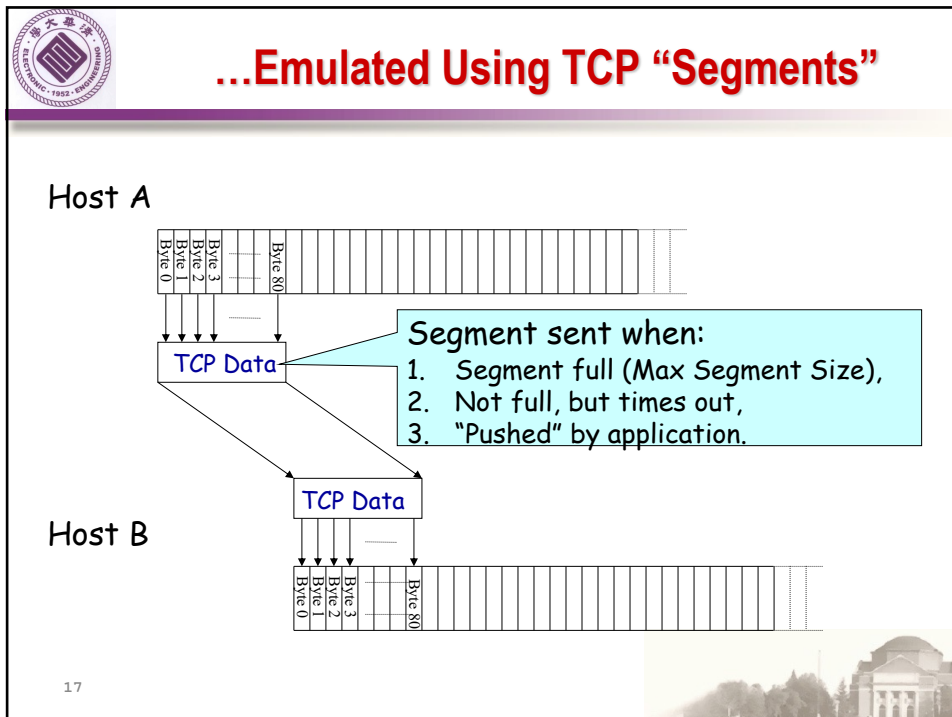


TCP “Stream of Bytes” Service

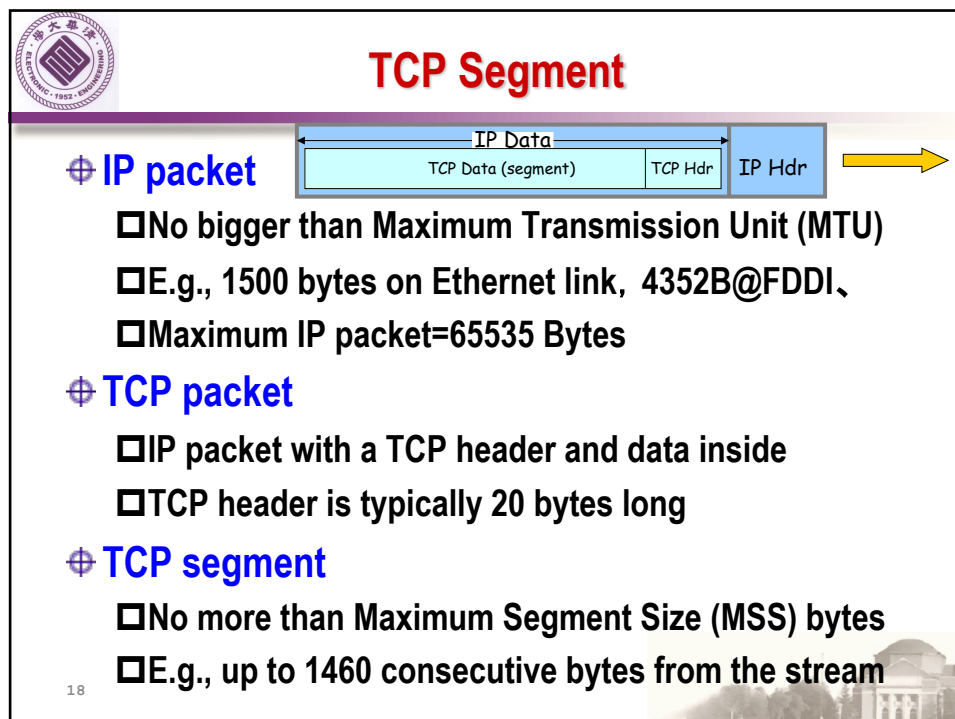




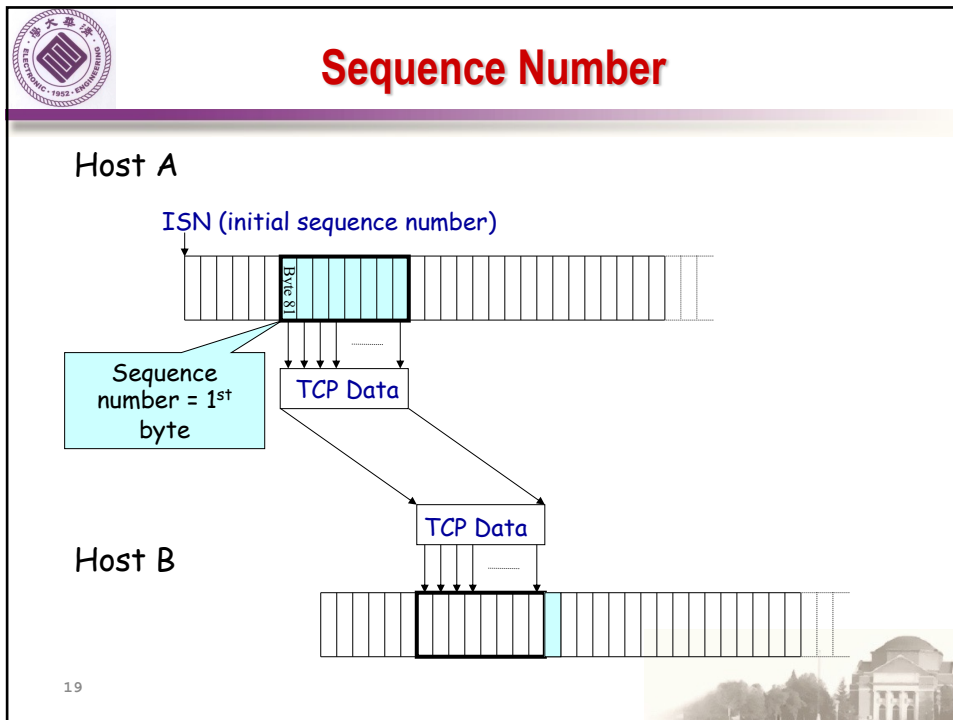
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17



18



19

Initial Sequence Number (ISN)

- ⊕ **Sequence number for the very first byte**
 - ❑ E.g., Why not a de facto ISN of 0?
- ⊕ **Practical issue: reuse of port numbers**
 - ❑ Port numbers must (eventually) get used again (same socket/different connection)
 - ❑ and an old packet may still be in flight, but associated with the new connection. (fake attack)
- ⊕ **So, TCP must change the ISN over time**
 - ❑ Set from a 32-bit clock that ticks every 4 microsec
 - ❑ ... which wraps around once every 4.55 hours!

20



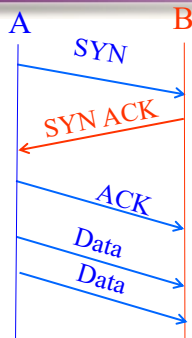
STARTING AND ENDING A CONNECTION: TCP HANDSHAKES



21



Establishing a TCP Connection



Each host tells its ISN to the other host.

⊕ **Three-way handshake to establish connection**

- ❑ Host A sends a **SYN** (open) to the host B
- ❑ Host B returns a **SYN acknowledgment (SYN ACK)**
- ❑ Host A sends an **ACK** to acknowledge the SYN ACK



22



TCP Header

Flags: SYN
FIN
RST
PSH
URG
ACK

Source port		Destination port	
Sequence number			
Acknowledgment			
HdrLen	0	Flags	Advertised window
Checksum		Urgent pointer	
Options (variable)			
Data			

23



Step 1: A's Initial SYN Packet

Flags: **SYN**
FIN
RST
PSH
URG
ACK

A's port		B's port	
A's Initial Sequence Number			
Acknowledgment			
20	0	Flags	Advertised window
Checksum		Urgent pointer	
Options (variable)			

A tells B it wants to open a connection...

24



Step 2: B's SYN-ACK Packet

Flags: SYN
FIN
RST
PSH
URG
ACK

B's port		A's port	
B's Initial Sequence Number			
A's ISN plus 1			
20	0	Flags	Advertised window
Checksum		Urgent pointer	
Options (variable)			

**B tells A it accepts, and is ready to hear the next byte...
... upon receiving this packet, A can start sending data**

25



25



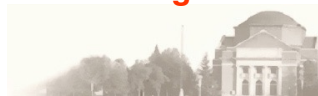
Step 3: A's ACK of the SYN-ACK

Flags: SYN
FIN
RST
PSH
URG
ACK

A's port			B's port		
Sequence number					
B's ISN plus 1					
20	0	Flags	Advertised window		
Checksum			Urgent pointer		
Options (variable)					

**A tells B it is okay to start sending
... upon receiving this packet, B can start sending data**

26



26



What if the SYN Packet Gets Lost?

- ⊕ **Suppose the SYN packet gets lost**
 - ❑ Packet is lost inside the network, or
 - ❑ Server rejects the packet (e.g., listen queue is full)
- ⊕ **Eventually, no SYN-ACK arrives**
 - ❑ Sender sets a timer and wait for the SYN-ACK
 - ❑ ... and retransmits the SYN if needed
- ⊕ **How should the TCP sender set the timer?**
 - ❑ Sender has no idea how far away the receiver is
 - ❑ Some TCPs use a default of 3 or 6 seconds

27

27

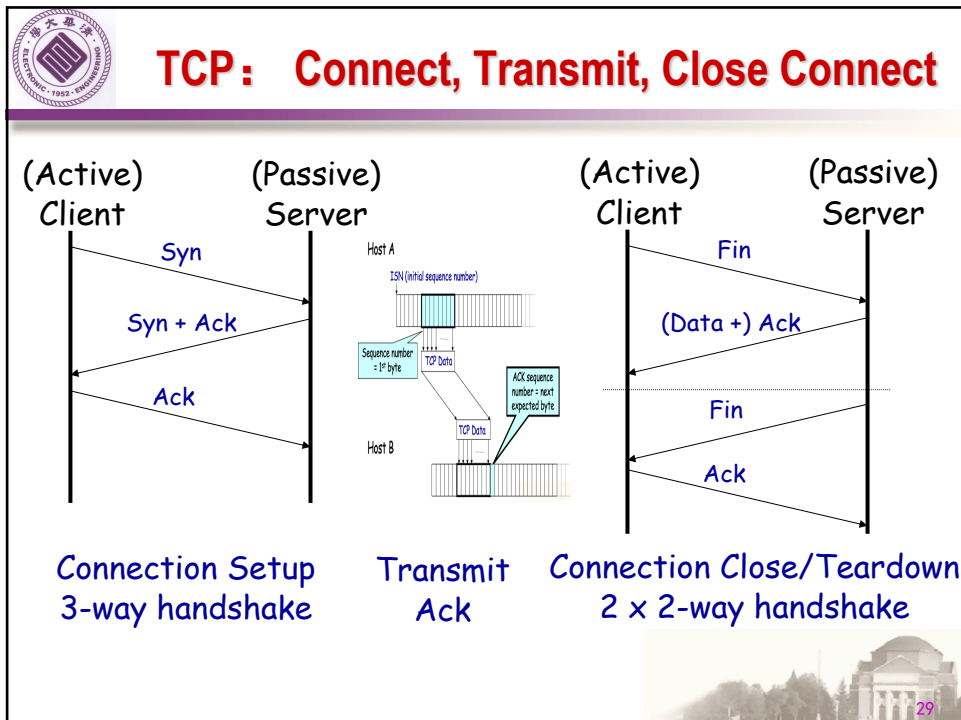


SYN Loss and Web Downloads

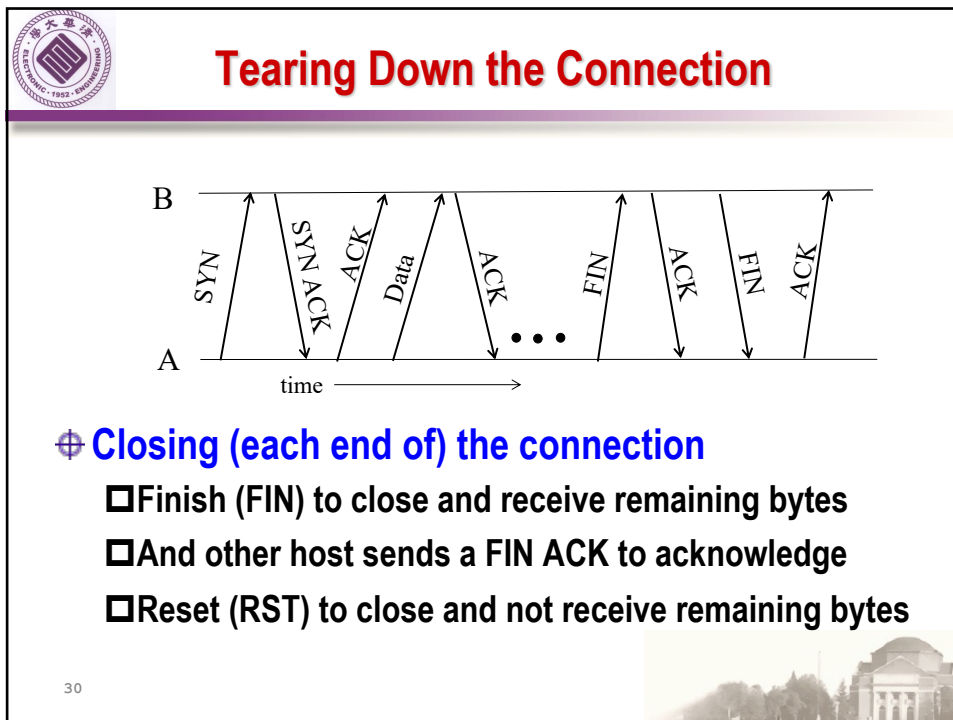
- ⊕ **User clicks on a hypertext link**
 - ❑ Browser creates a socket and does a “connect”
 - ❑ The “connect” triggers the OS to transmit a SYN
- ⊕ **If the SYN is lost...**
 - ❑ The 3-6 seconds of delay is very long
 - ❑ The impatient user may click “reload”
- ⊕ **User triggers an “abort” of the “connect”**
 - ❑ Browser “connects” on a new socket
 - ❑ Essentially, forces a fast send of a new SYN!

28

28



29



30



Sending/Receiving the FIN Packet

⊕ Sending a FIN: close()

- ❑ Process is done sending data via the socket
- ❑ Process invokes “close()” to close the socket
- ❑ Once TCP has sent all the outstanding bytes...
- ❑ ... then TCP sends a FIN

⊕ Receiving a FIN: EOF

- ❑ Process is reading data from the socket
- ❑ Eventually, the attempt to read returns an EOF

31

31



RELIABLE DELIVERY ON A LOSSY CHANNEL WITH BIT ERRORS

32

32



Challenges of Reliable Data Transfer

- ⊕ **Over a perfectly reliable channel**
 - ❑ Easy: sender sends, and receiver receives
- ⊕ **Over a channel with bit errors**
 - ❑ Receiver detects errors and requests retransmission
- ⊕ **Over a lossy channel with bit errors**
 - ❑ Some data are missing, and others corrupted
 - ❑ Receiver cannot always detect loss
- ⊕ **Over a channel that may reorder packets**
 - ❑ Receiver cannot distinguish loss from out-of-order

33

33



An Analogy

- ⊕ **Alice and Bob are talking**
 - ❑ What if Alice couldn't understand Bob?
 - ❑ Bob asks Alice to repeat what she said
- ⊕ **What if Bob hasn't heard Alice for a while?**
 - ❑ Is Alice just being quiet? Has she lost reception?
 - ❑ How long should Bob just keep on talking?
 - ❑ Maybe Alice should periodically say "uh huh"
 - ❑ ... or Bob should ask "Can you hear me now?" 😊



34

34



Take-Aways from the Example

- ⊕ **Acknowledgments from receiver**
 - Positive: “okay” or “uh huh” or “ACK”
 - Negative: “please repeat that” or “NACK”
- ⊕ **Retransmission by the sender**
 - After *not* receiving an “ACK”
 - After receiving a “NACK”
- ⊕ **Timeout by the sender (“stop and wait”)**
 - Don’t wait forever without some acknowledgment

35

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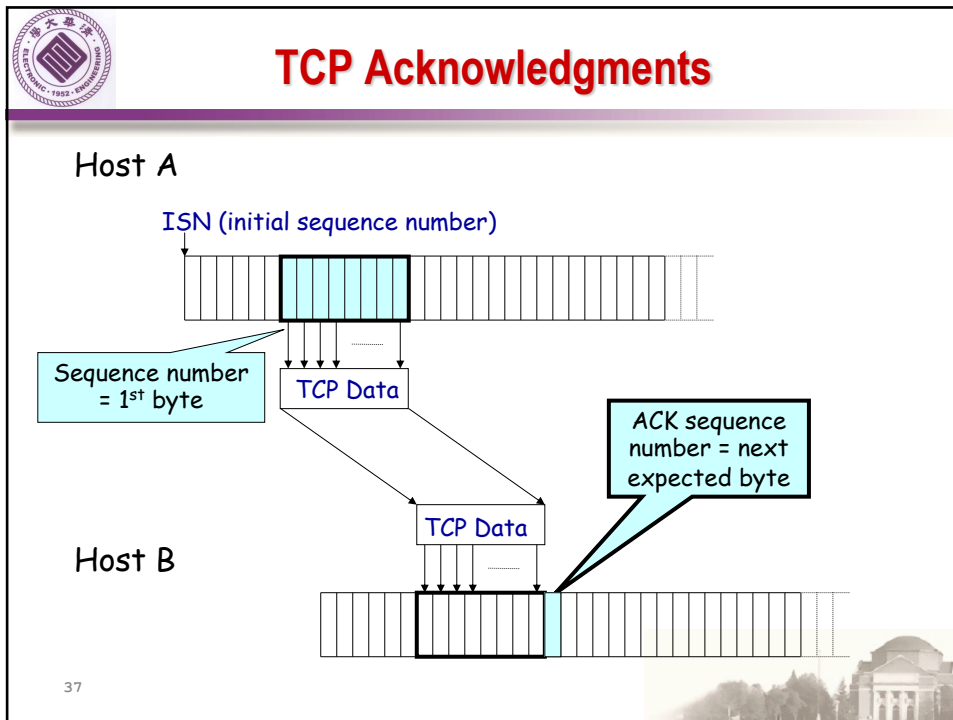


TCP Support for Reliable Delivery

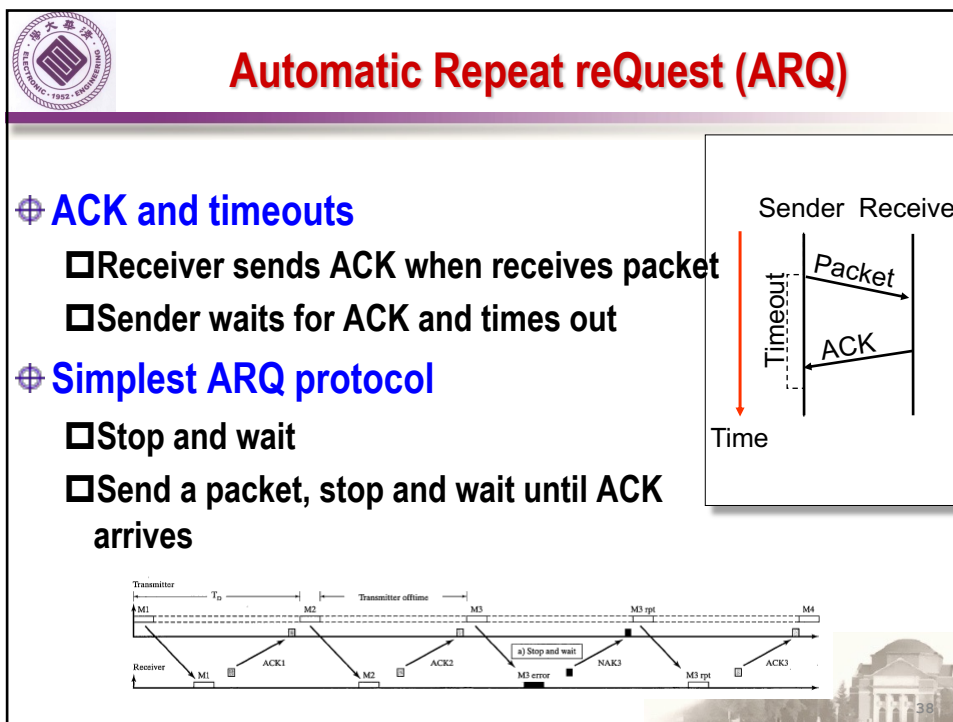
- ⊕ **Detect bit errors: checksum**
 - Used to detect corrupted data at the receiver
 - ...leading the receiver to drop the packet
- ⊕ **Detect missing data: sequence number**
 - Used to detect a gap in the stream of bytes
 - ... and for putting the data back in order
- ⊕ **Recover from lost data: retransmission**
 - Sender retransmits lost or corrupted data
 - Two main ways to detect lost packets

36

36



37

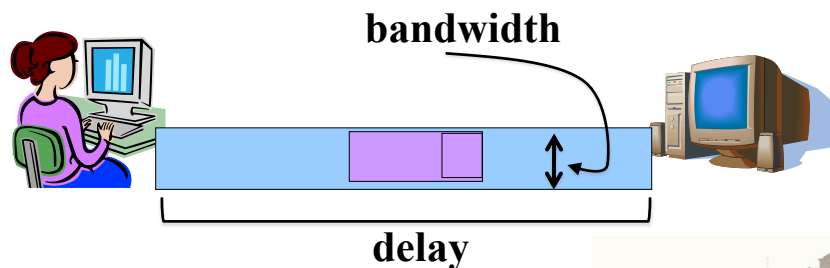


38



Stop-and-wait is inefficient

- ❑ Only one TCP segment is “in flight” at a time
- ❑ Especially bad for high “delay-bandwidth product”

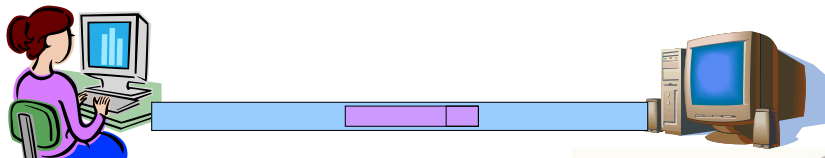


39



Numerical Example

- ⊕ 1.5 Mbps link with 45 msec round-trip time (RTT)
 - ❑ Delay-bandwidth product is 67.5 Kbits (or 8 KBytes)
- ⊕ Sender can send at most one packet per RTT
 - ❑ Assuming a segment size of 1 KB (8 Kbits)
 - ❑ 8 Kbits/segment at 45 msec/segment → 182 Kbps
 - ❑ That's just *one-eighth* of the 1.5 Mbps link capacity

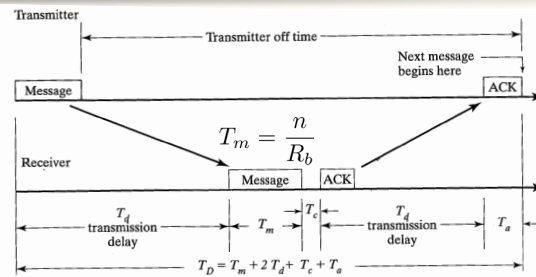


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Stop and wait



$$T_D = T_m + 2T_d + T_c + T_a$$

$$\widehat{R}_b = R_b \frac{T_m}{T_D}$$

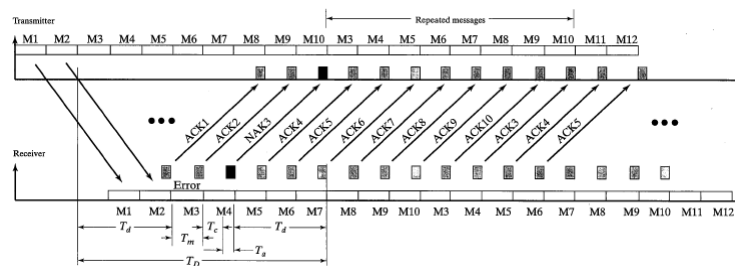
$$\widehat{R}_b = R_b \frac{T_m}{\sum_i T_{D-i}}$$



41



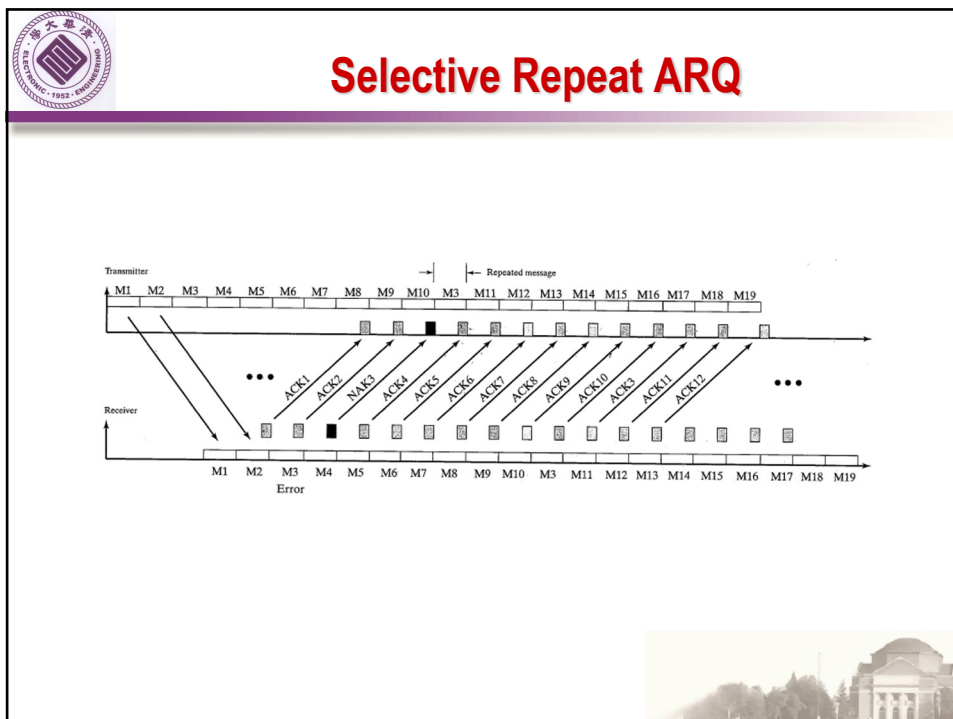
Go-Back-N ARQ



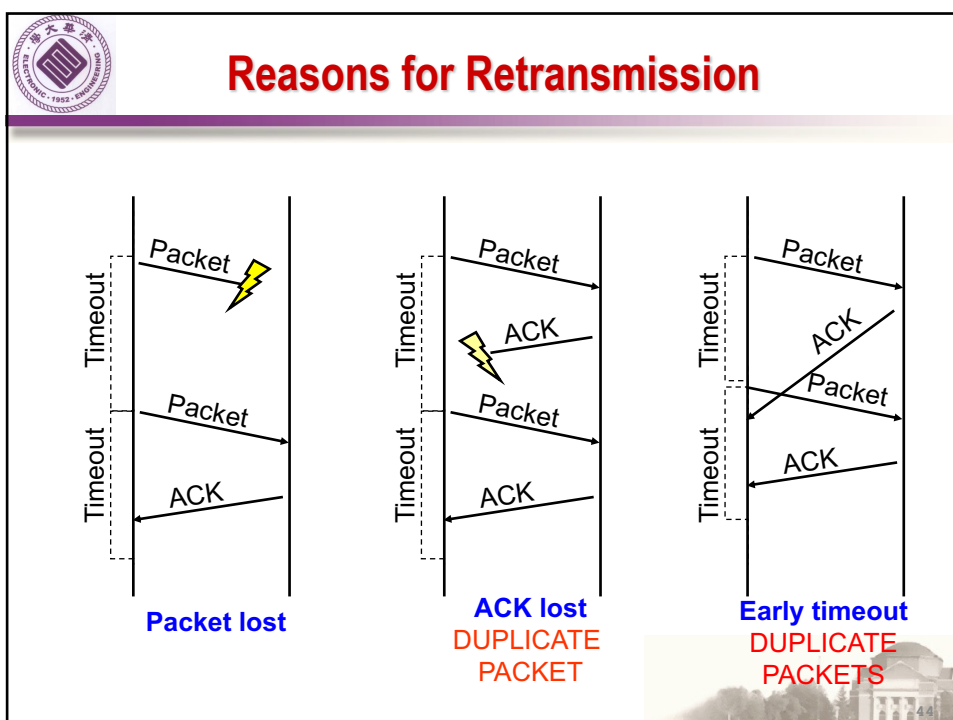
TCP's Retransmission policy is "Go Back N".



42



43



44



How Long Should Sender Wait?

- ⊕ **Sender sets a timeout to wait for an ACK**
 - ❑ Too short: wasted retransmissions
 - ❑ Too long: excessive delays when packet lost
- ⊕ **TCP sets timeout as a function of the RTT**
 - ❑ Expect ACK to arrive after an “round-trip time”
- ⊕ **But, how does the sender know the RTT?**
 - ❑ Running average of delay to receive an ACK

45

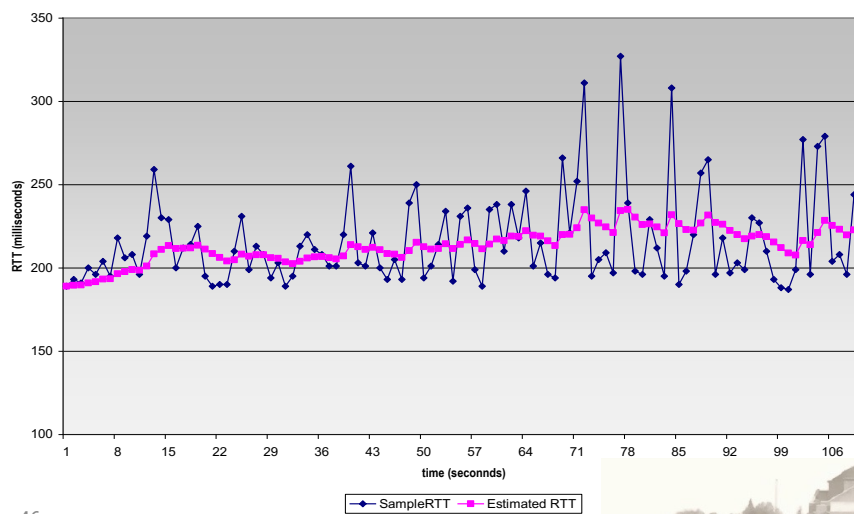


45



Example RTT Estimation

RTT: gaia.cs.umass.edu to fantasia.eurecom.fr



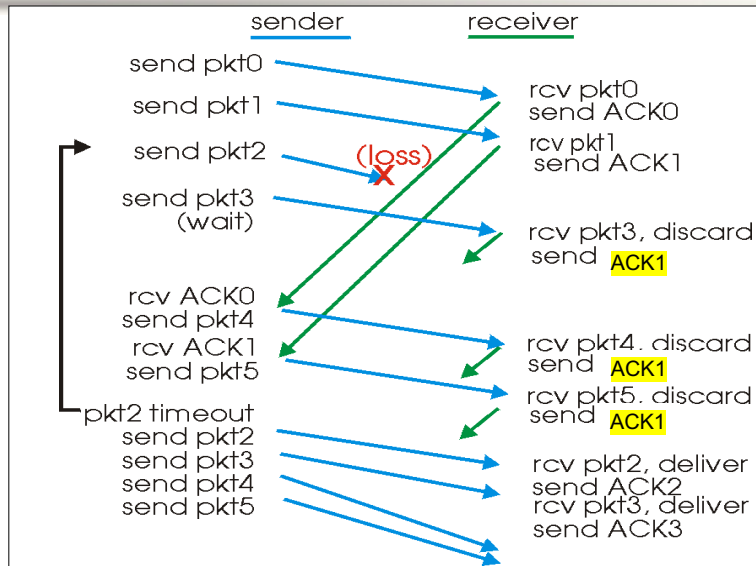
46



46



Still, Timeouts are Inefficient



47

47



Fast Retransmission

⊕ When packet n is lost...

- ... packets $n+1$, $n+2$, and so on may get through

⊕ Exploit the ACKs of these packets

- ACK says receiver is still awaiting n th packet
- Duplicate ACKs suggest later packets arrived
- Sender uses "duplicate ACKs" as a hint

⊕ Fast retransmission

- Retransmit after "triple duplicate ACK"

48

48



Effectiveness of Fast Retransmit

⊕ When does Fast Retransmit work best?

- ❑ High likelihood of many packets in flight
- ❑ Long data transfers, large window size, ...

⊕ Implications for Web traffic

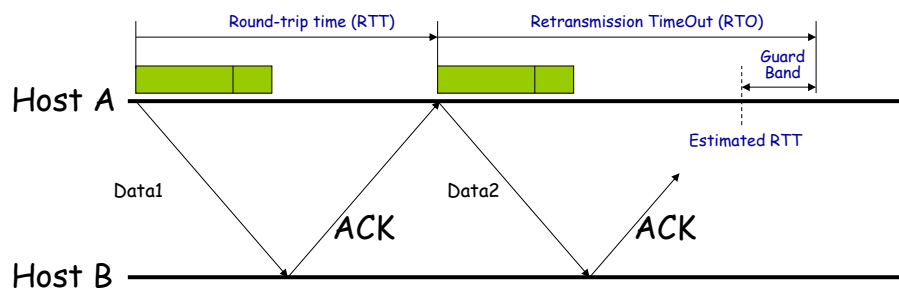
- ❑ Most Web transfers are short (e.g., 10 packets)
So, often there aren't many packets in flight
- ❑ Making fast retransmit is less likely to “kick in”
Forcing users to click “reload” more often... 😊

49

49



TCP: Retransmission and Timeouts



TCP uses an adaptive retransmission timeout value:
Congestion } RTT changes frequently
Changes in Routing }

50

50



RTO: Retransmission Time Out

Picking the RTO is important:

- ❖ Pick a values that's too big and it will wait too long to retransmit a packet,
- ❖ Pick a value too small, and it will unnecessarily retransmit packets.

The original algorithm for picking RTO:

1. $\text{EstimatedRTT}_k = (1 - \alpha) \text{EstimatedRTT}_{k-1} + \alpha \text{SampleRTT}$
2. $\text{RTO} = 2 * \text{EstimatedRTT}$

Determined empirically

empirical value is 12.5%

Characteristics of the original algorithm:

- ❖ Variance is assumed to be fixed.
- ❖ But in practice, variance increases as congestion increases.

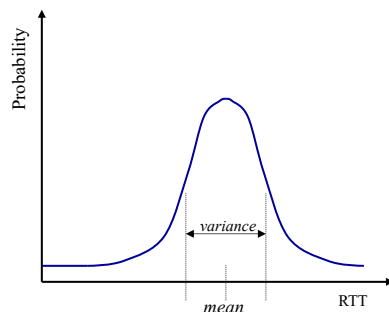


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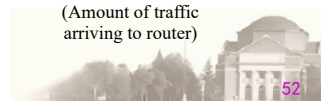
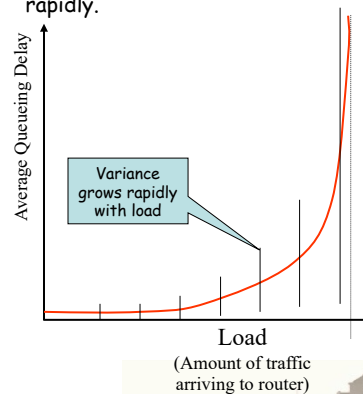


TCP: Retransmission and Timeouts

- ❖ There will be some (unknown) distribution of RTTs.
- ❖ We are trying to estimate an RTO to minimize the probability of a false timeout.



- ❖ Router queues grow when there is more traffic, until they become unstable.
- ❖ As load grows, variance of delay grows rapidly.



52



TCP: Retransmission and Timeouts

Newer Algorithm includes estimate of variance in RTT:

- ❖ $\text{Difference} = \text{SampleRTT} - \text{EstimatedRTT}$
- ❖ $\text{EstimatedRTT}_k = \text{EstimatedRTT}_{k-1} + (\delta * \text{Difference})$
- ❖ $\text{Deviation} = \text{Deviation} + \delta * (|\text{Difference}| - \text{Deviation})$
- ❖ $\text{RTO} = \mu * \text{EstimatedRTT} + \phi * \text{Deviation}$
 $\mu \approx 1$
 $\phi \approx 4$

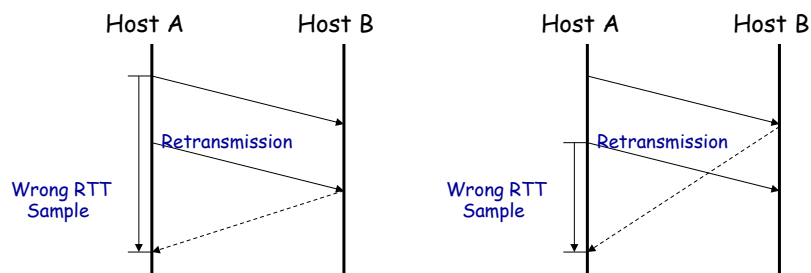


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TCP: Retransmission and Timeouts *Karn's Algorithm*



Problem:

How can we estimate RTT when packets are retransmitted?

Solution:

On retransmission, don't update estimated RTT (and double RTO).



54

54